

# Prefix-Primitive Annihilators of Languages \*

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## Abstract

*This paper studies algebraic properties concerning the  $p$ -primitive annihilators of languages. The  $p$ -primitive annihilators of languages contains left  $P_1$ -annihilators and right  $P_1$ -annihilators. There are some interesting results presented in this paper. Such as: for every finite language  $L$ , the left  $P_1$ -annihilator of  $L$  is not equal to the right  $P_1$ -annihilator of  $L$ , the set  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not regular for any finite language  $L$ , and the set  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not empty for any thin language.*

## 1 Introduction

The theory of formal languages plays a considerable role in the field of computer science. Both regular languages and disjunctive languages are especially important applications. Recall that every regular language is accepted by a finite automaton [6]. It is the union of the equivalence classes of a congruence relation of finite index. Moreover, from the definition of disjunctive languages, every disjunctive language has infinitely many congruence classes. This yields that no disjunctive language is regular. For a given language  $L \subseteq X^*$ , the relation  $P_L$  defined on  $X^*$  by

$$u \equiv v(P_L) \Leftrightarrow (xuy \in L \Leftrightarrow xvy \in L, \forall x, y \in X^*)$$

is a congruence. A language  $L$  is *regular* if  $P_L$  is of finite index and is *disjunctive* if  $P_L$  is the equality.

A word  $f \in X^+$  is a *primitive word* if  $f$  is not a power of any other word. It is known that every nonempty word is a power of a primitive word and the expression is unique. The set of all primitive

words over  $X$  is, by the standard way, denoted by  $Q$ . (see [8], [11]) No beginning square words are introduced and studied in [2] and [4]. Since every no beginning square word is primitive, no beginning square words are called prefix primitive words, shortly  *$p$ -primitive words*. The set of all  $p$ -primitive words over  $X$  is denoted by  $P_1$ .

The concept of annihilators of languages is proposed by Shyr and Yu in [10]. This is somewhat like the T-conductor of a vector into a given subspace studied in linear algebra. When a binary operation is applied to a given language with another language, we would like to know what family of languages the other language can be chosen from such that the result belongs to a specific family. Let  $\mathcal{F}$  be a family of languages and  $L$  is a language. Then a language  $A$  is called a right  $\mathcal{F}$ -annihilator of  $L$  if  $LA$  is a language in  $\mathcal{F}$  and a language  $B$  is called left  $\mathcal{F}$ -annihilator of  $L$  if  $BL$  is a language in  $\mathcal{F}$ . There are many annihilators had been studied, such as  $Q$ -annihilators [10],  $\mathcal{D}$ -annihilators [12],  $\mathcal{P}$ -annihilators [12] and  $d$ -primitive annihilators [13]. Let  $\mathcal{S}$  be the family of all  $p$ -primitive languages. Then we denote  $p$ -primitive annihilators of languages by  $\mathcal{S}$ -annihilators. There are many different properties between  $\mathcal{S}$ -annihilators and  $Q$ -annihilators,  $\mathcal{D}$ -annihilators,  $\mathcal{P}$ -annihilators. For example, the catenation of languages is  $Q$ -commutative but is not  $\mathcal{S}$ -commutative. This provides us the initial motivation for studying  $p$ -primitive annihilators of languages.

## 2 Definitions and Preliminaries

Let  $X$  be a finite alphabet and  $X^*$  be the free monoid generated by  $X$ . Any element of  $X^*$  is called a *word*. For any word  $u \in X^*$ , let  $\lg(u)$  be

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the length of  $u$ , which is the number of letters occurring in  $u$ . Any subset of  $X^*$  is called a *language* over  $X$ . Let  $X^+ = X^* \setminus \{\lambda\}$ , where  $\lambda$  is the empty word. A word  $w \in X^+$  is said to be *primitive* if  $w = u^n$  with  $u \in X^+$  implies  $n = 1$ . It is known that every nonempty word is a power of a primitive word and the expression is unique. The set of all primitive words over  $X$  is denoted by  $Q$ . The system  $\langle X^*, \circ \rangle$  is known as a free monoid, where the operation  $\circ$  is the catenation of two words. For convenience, for any  $u, v \in X^*$ , let  $u \circ v = uv$ . The catenation of two languages  $A$  and  $B$  is defined to be the set  $A \circ B = AB = \{xy \mid x \in A, y \in B\}$ . For a language  $L$ , let  $L^{(i)} = \{w^i \mid w \in L\}$  for any  $i \geq 1$ .

The partial order relation  $\leq_p$  (resp.,  $\leq_s$ ) is defined as: for  $u, v \in X^*$ ,  $u \leq_p v$  (resp.,  $u \leq_s v$ ) if  $v \in uX^*$  (resp.,  $v \in X^*u$ ). A word  $u$  is said to be a *prefix* (resp., *suffix*) of another word  $w$  if  $u \leq_p w$  (resp.,  $v \leq_s w$ ). For a given word  $u \in X^+$ , we define the infix of the word  $u$  as  $E(u) = \{v \in X^+ \mid u \in X^*vX^*\}$ . The partial order relation  $\leq_d$  is defined as: for  $u, v \in X^*$ ,  $u \leq_d v$  if  $v = ux = yu$  for some  $x, y \in X^*$ . Note that  $1 \leq_d v$  for any  $v \in X^+$ . For a word  $u \in X^+$ , let  $\text{Pref}(u) = \{v \in X^+ \mid v \leq_p u\}$  and  $\text{Suff}(u) = \{v \in X^+ \mid v \leq_s u\}$ . For a language  $L \subseteq X^*$ , let  $L_p = \{v \in X^+ \mid v \leq_p u, \text{ for some } u \in L\}$  and  $L_s = \{v \in X^+ \mid v \leq_s u, \text{ for some } u \in L\}$ .

A word  $w$  is said to be *prefix primitive* (shortly, *p-primitive*), i.e.,  $w \notin u^2X^*$  for any  $u \in X^+$ . The set of all p-primitive words over  $X$  is denoted by  $P_1$ . For example: let  $X = \{a, b\}$ . Then  $ab^n$  is a p-primitive word for any  $n \geq 1$ . It is clear that  $P_1$  is a subset of  $Q$ . A word  $u$  is a *conjugate* of another word  $v$  if there is a word  $w$  such that  $uw = wv$ . A word  $u \in X^+$  is said to be *d-primitive* if for any  $v \in X^+$ ,  $v \leq_d u$  implies  $u = v$ . Let  $D(1)$  be the set of all d-primitive words in  $X^*$  ([3]). It is clear that  $D(1)$  is also a subset of  $Q$ .

Let  $L \subseteq X^+$  be a language and  $\mathcal{F}$  be a family of languages. The right  $\mathcal{F}$ -annihilating function on  $2^{X^+}$ , denoted  $\alpha_{\mathcal{F}}$ , is defined by  $\alpha_{\mathcal{F}}(L) = \{Y \subseteq X^+ \mid LY \in \mathcal{F}\}$  ([12]). Every element in  $\alpha_{\mathcal{F}}(L)$  is called a right  $\mathcal{F}$ -annihilator of the language  $L$ . Dually, the left  $\mathcal{F}$ -annihilating function on  $2^{X^+}$ , denoted  $\gamma_{\mathcal{F}}$ , is defined by  $\gamma_{\mathcal{F}}(L) = \{Y \subseteq X^+ \mid YL \in \mathcal{F}\}$ .

### 3 The $P_1$ -Annihilators of Languages

Some algebraic properties of annihilators concerning p-primitive languages are studied in this section. Let  $L \subseteq X^+$  be a language and  $P_1$  be the set of all p-primitive words. The right  $P_1$ -annihilating function on  $2^{X^+}$ , denoted  $\alpha_{P_1}$ , is defined by  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \{w \in X^+ \mid Lw \subseteq P_1\}$ . Every element in  $\alpha_{P_1}(L)$  is called a right  $P_1$ -annihilator of the language  $L$ . Dually, the left  $P_1$ -annihilating function on  $2^{X^+}$ , denoted  $\gamma_{P_1}$ , is defined by  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) = \{w \in X^+ \mid wL \subseteq P_1\}$ . We give some examples of annihilators of p-primitive languages.

**Example 3.1** Let  $X$  be an alphabet. Then

- (1)  $\alpha_{P_1}(X) = \emptyset$ , and  $\alpha_{P_1}(P_1) = \emptyset$ .
- (2) For any  $a \in X$ ,  $\alpha_{P_1}(\{a\}) = (X \setminus \{a\})X^* \setminus \{xaxy \mid x \in X^+, y \in X^*\}$ .
- (3) For any  $a \in X$ ,  $\gamma_{P_1}(\{a\}) = P_1 \setminus \{xax \mid x \in X^+\}$ .

From the definitions of right  $P_1$ -annihilators and left  $P_1$ -annihilators, the following results are clear.

**Lemma 3.1** ([1]) *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$ . The following statements are true:*

- (1) *If  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$ , then  $L \subseteq P_1$ .*
- (2) *If  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$ , then  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) \subseteq P_1$ .*

**Lemma 3.2** ([1]) *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$ . Then if  $u \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ , then  $v \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ , for every  $v \leq_p u$ .*

**Proposition 3.1** *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$ . The following statements are true:*

- (1) *If  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \emptyset$ , then  $\alpha_{P_1}(A) = \emptyset$ , for every language  $A \supseteq L$ .*
- (2) *If  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) = \emptyset$ , then  $\gamma_{P_1}(B) = \emptyset$ , for every language  $B \supseteq L$ .*

*Proof.* We only show that Statement (1) is true and the proof of Statement (2) is similar. Since  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \emptyset$ , we have that  $Lu \not\subseteq P_1$  for every  $u \in X^*$ . That is, for every  $u \in X^*$ , there exists a word  $w \in L$  such that  $wu \notin P_1$ . This implies that for every  $u \in X^*$  there exists  $w \in L \subseteq A$  such that  $wu \notin P_1$ . Hence  $Au \not\subseteq P_1$ . That is,  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \emptyset$ . #

From Example 3.1, we see that  $\alpha_{P_1}(\{a\}) \neq \gamma_{P_1}(\{a\})$ . That is,  $\alpha_{P_1}(L)$  need not equal to  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$ , for any  $L \subseteq X^*$ . We now give some languages  $L$  such that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ .

**Lemma 3.3** *Let  $a \neq b \in X$  and let  $L = \{ba^{\lg(u)+1}uba^{\lg(u)+1} \mid u \in X^+ \setminus \{a\}\}$ . Then  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \gamma_{P_1}(L) = \{a\}$ . Indeed, by the definition of  $\lg(u)$ , we have that  $ba^{\lg(u)+1}uba^{\lg(u)+1} \in P_1$ . That is,  $L \subseteq P_1$ . For any  $u \in X^+ \setminus \{a\}$ , it is clear that  $Lu = \emptyset$  and  $La \subseteq P_1$ . That is,  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \{a\}$ . On the other hand, it is clear that  $aL \subseteq P_1$  and  $uL = \emptyset$  for any  $u \in X^+ \setminus \{a\}$ . That is,  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) = \{a\}$ . Thus  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \gamma_{P_1}(L) = \{a\}$ .*

**Example 3.2** Let  $a \neq b \in X$  and let  $L = \{ba^{\lg(u)+1}uba^{\lg(u)+1} \mid u \in X^+ \setminus \{a, ab\}\}$ . Then  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \gamma_{P_1}(L) = \{a, ab\}$ . Indeed, by the definition of  $\lg(u)$ , we have that  $ba^{\lg(u)+1}uba^{\lg(u)+1} \in P_1$ . That is,  $L \subseteq P_1$ . For any  $u \in X^+ \setminus \{a, ab\}$ , it is clear that  $Lu = \emptyset$  and  $Lab, La \subseteq P_1$ . That is,  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \{a, ab\}$ . On the other hand, it is clear that  $aL, abL \subseteq P_1$  and  $uL = \emptyset$  for any  $u \in X^+ \setminus \{a, ab\}$ . That is,  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) = \{a, ab\}$ . Thus  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \gamma_{P_1}(L) = \{a, ab\}$ .

A language  $L \subseteq X^*$  is *dense* if for any  $w \in X^*$ , there exist  $x, y \in X^*$  such that  $xwy \in L$ . That is, for every  $w \in X^*$ ,  $X^*wX^* \cap L \neq \emptyset$ . A language is called *thin* if it is not dense. In the rest of this section, we show that every thin language  $L$ , the left  $P_1$ -annihilator  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not empty. First, we give some known lemmata we need. From the definitions of  $\alpha_{P_1}$  and  $\gamma_{P_1}$ , it is clear that  $\alpha_{P_1}(X) = \emptyset$  and  $\gamma_{P_1}(X^*) = \emptyset$ . Let  $L \subseteq X^+$ . In Proposition 3.2, we give characteristics for that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$  and  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$ .

**Lemma 3.4** ([2]) *Let  $u, v$  be two distinct words with  $u \in P_1(X)$ . Then  $uv$  is a  $p$ -primitive word if and only if none of the following statements holds:*

- (1)  $u <_p v$ ,
- (2)  $u = x_1x_2x_1$  with  $x_2 \leq_p v$  where  $x_1, x_2 \in X^+$ ,  
or
- (3)  $v = x_1ux_1y$  where  $x_1 \in X^+$ ,  $y \in X^*$ .

**Proposition 3.2** ([1]) *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$ . The following statements are true:*

- (1)  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$  if and only if  $L \subseteq P_1$  and  $La \subseteq Q$  for some  $a \in X$ .

- (2)  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$  if and only if there exists a  $p$ -primitive word, say  $u \in P_1$ , such that both of the following conditions hold:

- (i)  $xux \notin L_p$  for every  $x \in X^*$ , and
- (ii)  $u \notin yL_py$  for every  $y \in X^+$ .

From above proposition, the following remark is trivial:

**Remark 3.1** *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$ . The following statements are true:*

- (1)  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \emptyset$  if and only if one of the following conditions holds: (i)  $L \not\subseteq P_1$ , (ii)  $L \subseteq P_1$  and  $La \not\subseteq Q$  for every  $a \in X$ .
- (2)  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) = \emptyset$  if and only if, for every  $u \in P_1$ , one of the following conditions holds: (i)  $xux \in L_p$  for some  $x \in X^*$ , (ii)  $u \in yL_py$  for some  $y \in X^+$ .
- (3) If  $L \subseteq P_1$  and  $La \subseteq Q$  for some  $a \in X$ , then  $La \subseteq P_1$  and then  $a \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . Moreover,  $xax \notin L$  for every  $x \in X^*$ .
- (4) If  $u \in P_1$  such that both of (i)  $xux \notin L_p$  for every  $x \in X^*$ , and (ii)  $u \notin yL_py$  for every  $y \in X^+$  are true, then  $u \in \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . Moreover,  $zuv \notin L$  for every  $z, v \in X^*$ .

**Proposition 3.3** *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$ . If  $L$  is thin, then  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$ .*

*Proof.* Suppose that  $L$  is thin. Then there exists a word  $w \in X^+$  such that  $L \cap X^*wX^* = \emptyset$ . Let  $a \neq b \in X$  and let  $u = ba^{\lg(w)}wba^{\lg(w)}$ . It is clear that  $u \in P_1$ . We claim that  $u \in \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . On the other contrary, assume that  $u \notin \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . Then there exists  $v \in L$  such that  $uv \notin P_1$ . This in conjunction with  $u \in P_1$ , there exists  $z \in X^+$  with  $z \leq_p v$  such that  $uz = f^2$ , where  $f \in Q$ . That is,  $ba^{\lg(w)}wba^{\lg(w)}z = f^2$ . This implies that  $f = ba^{\lg(w)}w$  or  $ba^{\lg(w)}wba^{\lg(w)} \leq_p f$ . If  $f = ba^{\lg(w)}w$ , then  $z = w$ . This implies that  $w = z \leq_p v$  and then  $w \in L_p$ . This contradicts to  $L \cap X^*wX^* = \emptyset$ . If  $ba^{\lg(w)}wba^{\lg(w)} \leq_p f$ , then there exists  $x \in X^*$ ,  $y \in X^+$  with  $v = xy$  such that  $f = ba^{\lg(w)}wba^{\lg(w)}x = y$ . This implies  $xba^{\lg(w)}wba^{\lg(w)}x = xy = v \in L$ . Thus  $L \cap X^*wX^* \neq \emptyset$ , a contradiction. Hence  $u = ba^{\lg(w)}wba^{\lg(w)} \in \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . #

A language is a 2-code if for every two distinct words in the language constructs a code. ([11]) That is,  $L \subseteq X^+$  is a 2-code if for every  $u, v \in L$ ,  $\{u, v\}$  is a code.

**Proposition 3.4** ([1]) *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$  be a language. If  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$ , then  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is a 2-code.*

For the case right  $P_1$ -annihilators, the above propositions are not true. Indeed, if  $L = X$ , then  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \emptyset$  and hence Propositions 3.3 and 3.4 are not true.

## 4 The $P_1$ -Annihilators of finite languages

In this section we consider some algebraic properties of p-primitive annihilators for finite languages. We also investigate the relation between left  $P_1$ -annihilators and right  $P_1$ -annihilators for finite languages. First we give a known result.

**Proposition 4.1** ([1]) *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$  be a finite language. Then  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is dense. Hence  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not an empty set.*

In the following, we show that  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not regular for any finite languages. Note that a language  $L$  is *regular* if  $P_L$  is of finite index and is *disjunctive* if  $P_L$  is the equality. The union of two disjunctive languages is not necessarily disjunctive. It is known that  $Q$  is disjunctive and  $Q^{(i)}$  is regular for any  $i \geq 2$ .

From the definitions of disjunctivity and regularity it is clear that a regular language can never be disjunctive and also a disjunctive language can never be regular. To show that the left p-primitive annihilators of finite languages is not regular, we need the following lemma.

**Lemma 4.1** ([7]) *Let  $L \subseteq X^*$ . Then  $L$  is disjunctive if and only if for any two words  $u$  and  $v$  with the same length,  $u \equiv v(P_L)$  implies  $u = v$ .*

The concept of quasi-disjunctive pairs ([3]), ([9]) is useful for showing the disjunctivities of languages. For two disjoint nonempty languages  $L_1, L_2 \subseteq X^*$ , the pair  $(L_1, L_2)$  is said to be a *quasi-disjunctive pair* if for any two distinct words  $u, v \in X^*$  with  $\lg(u) = \lg(v)$ , there exist  $x, y \in X^*$  such that  $xuy \in L_1$  and  $xvy \notin L_2$ , or vice versa. From Lemma 4.1, it is clear that if  $(L_1, L_2)$  is a quasi-disjunctive pair, then  $L_1$  and  $L_2$  are disjunctive.

**Proposition 4.2** *Let  $L \subseteq X^+$  be a finite language. Then  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is disjunctive. That is,  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not regular.*

*Proof.* Let  $L \subseteq X^+$  be a finite language. Then there exists a positive number  $m \geq 1$  such that  $m = \max\{\lg(z) \mid z \in L\}$ . To prove our result is to show that  $(\gamma_{P_1}(L), X^+ \setminus \gamma_{P_1}(L))$  is a quasi-disjunctive pair. Assume that  $u \neq v \in X^n$  for any  $n \geq 1$ . Let  $x = ba^{m+n+1}$ ,  $y = wba^{m+n+1}u$  for some  $w \in L$  with  $\lg(w) = m$ . Then  $xuy = ba^{m+n+1}uwba^{m+n+1}u$  and  $xvy = ba^{m+n+1}vwba^{m+n+1}u$ . From  $xuy = ba^{m+n+1}uwba^{m+n+1}u$ , since  $w \in L$ , we have that  $xuyw = (ba^{m+n+1}uw)^2$ . Thus  $xuyL \not\subseteq P_1$ , that is,  $xuy \notin \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . On the other hand, from  $xvy = ba^{m+n+1}vwba^{m+n+1}u$ , we have that  $xvyL \subseteq P_1$ , that is,  $xvy \in \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . By Lemma 4.1,  $(\gamma_{P_1}(L), X^+ \setminus \gamma_{P_1}(L))$  is a quasi-disjunctive pair. Thus  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is disjunctive, hence  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not regular. #

The result is not true for right annihilator. That is, there exists a finite language  $L \subseteq X^+$  such that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L)$  is finite. We give some examples as follows. Let  $X = \{a, b\}$ .

**Example 4.1** Let  $L = \{ab, ba, ba^2b, ab^3a\}$ . Then it is clear that  $a, b \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . But  $a^2, ab, ba, b^2 \notin \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . Since  $X^+ = \{a, b\} \cup \{a^2, ab, ba, b^2\}X^*$ , we have that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \{a, b\}$  is finite.

**Example 4.2** Let  $L = \{ba^3b, ba^2b^2, ba^2baba, bab^3, aba^3, ab^2abab, ab^2a^2, ab^3a\}$ . Then it is clear that  $a^2, ab, ba, b^2 \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$  and by Lemma 3.2,  $a, b \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . But  $a^3, a^2b, aba, ab^2, ba^2, bab, b^2a, b^3 \notin \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . Since  $X^+ = X \cup X^2 \cup X^3X^*$ , we have that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \{a, b, a^2, ab, ba, b^2\}$  is finite.

**Proposition 4.3** *Let  $L$  be a finite language. Then  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) \neq \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ .*

*Proof.* Let  $L$  be a finite language. By Proposition 4.1,  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is dense. If  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \emptyset$ , then it is clear that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) \neq \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . Now suppose that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) \neq \emptyset$ . Then by Remark 3.1, there exists  $a \in X$  such that  $La \subseteq P_1$ , that is,  $a \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . Assume that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . This implies that  $a \in \gamma_{P_1}(L)$  and then  $a \notin L_p$ . Hence there exists another letter  $b$  such that  $b \in L_p$ . Thus  $b \notin \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . By assumption that  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ , we have that  $b \notin \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . On the other hand, since  $L$  is finite, there exists  $m \geq 1$  such that  $m = \max\{\lg(w) \mid w \in L\}$ . Hence  $ba^m u \in P_1$  for every  $u \in L$ . Thus  $ba^m \in \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ . This in conjunction with  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) = \gamma_{P_1}(L)$ , we get that  $ba^m \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . But by Lemma 3.2,  $b \in \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . This contradicts to that  $b \notin \alpha_{P_1}(L)$ . Hence  $\alpha_{P_1}(L) \neq \gamma_{P_1}(L)$  for any finite language  $L$ . #

## 5 Conclusion

This paper studies algebraic properties concerning the  $p$ -primitive annihilators of languages. The  $p$ -primitive annihilators of languages contains left  $P_1$ -annihilators and right  $P_1$ -annihilators. We show that for every finite language  $L$ , the left  $P_1$ -annihilator of  $L$  is not equal to the right  $P_1$ -annihilator of  $L$ . We also show that the set  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not regular for any finite language  $L$ . Moreover, the set  $\gamma_{P_1}(L)$  is not empty for any thin language. In future work, Languages  $L$  such that  $\gamma_{P_1}(L) = \alpha_{P_1}(L)$  will be investigated related algebraic properties.

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